AC-MOT: Optimization-Guided Adaptive Detector Operating-Point Control for Multi-Object Aerial Tracking

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Abstract

Multi-object tracking (MOT) in unmanned aerial vehicle (UAV) videos is challenging due to variations in object density, size, illumination, and blur. However, most tracking-by-detection systems use fixed detector settings that may not suit changing scene conditions. This paper proposes Adaptive Control for Multi-Object Tracking (AC-MOT), a training-free framework that dynamically adjusts the detector operating point, defined by the confidence threshold, non-maximum suppression (NMS) intersection-over-union (IoU) threshold, and input resolution. Using only the current frame and past tracking information, AC-MOT treats the detector operating point as an online control variable without modifying or retraining the detector or tracker. Initial optimization experiments reveal trade-offs among tracking accuracy, identity preservation, and computational efficiency, motivating a three-state controller. On the VisDrone2019 dataset, AC-MOT improves Higher Order Tracking Accuracy (HOTA) from 41.586 to 44.523, Multiple Object Tracking Accuracy (MOTA) from 9.876 to 27.871, and Identity F1 Score (IDF1) from 48.569 to 53.929 with ByteTrack, while reducing identity switches (IDS) from 1,341 to 1,016. With OATrack, MOTA increases from 28.165 to 34.483, IDF1 from 57.107 to 59.364, and IDS decreases from 773 to 604. Paired bootstrap analysis with 5,000 resamples supports improvements in HOTA, MOTA, IDF1, and IDS for both trackers. Cross-dataset evaluation on the UAVDT dataset, using the same fixed policy without retuning, improves MOTA by 17.601 and 3.267 points with ByteTrack and OATrack, respectively. These results show that adapting the detector operating point online can improve aerial MOT with limited computational overhead and no additional training.

Keywords: multi-object tracking, UAV video, adaptive inference, detector operating point, real-time image processing

1 Introduction

Unmanned aerial vehicles (UAVs) are widely used for traffic monitoring, surveillance, and search, and many of these tasks need multi-object tracking (MOT): every object must be detected in every frame and keep the same identity over time [1, 2]. Aerial video makes this hard. Objects are small, their number changes quickly, the camera moves, and illumination and blur change within one video [2–4]. Many of these applications also need results with low delay, so the processing cost matters as much as the accuracy.

The performance of aerial MOT depends on several factors, including the quality of object detection, the ability to associate objects across consecutive frames, and the computational resources available for processing. These factors are closely related, since errors in object detection can directly affect the tracking process. Missed detections may interrupt object trajectories, while false detections can lead to incorrect associations and identity switches. At the same time, improving detection accuracy often requires additional computation, which may increase processing time and limit real-time performance. Achieving a suitable balance between detection quality, tracking accuracy, identity consistency, and computational efficiency is therefore an important challenge in aerial MOT systems.

Most MOT systems follow the tracking-by-detection design. A detector finds the objects in each frame, and a tracker links the detections over time [5, 6]. Much research improves the tracker, for example its motion model or its association rules, and much research improves the detector itself. Far less attention is given to how the detector is running. In practice the detector uses one confidence threshold, one non-maximum-suppression (NMS) threshold, and one input resolution for the whole video. These three values form the detector operating point, and they decide which boxes reach the tracker.

A fixed operating point does not fit a scene that keeps changing. A setting that works in a sparse, clear scene can keep too much clutter in a dense scene. A setting that works in a dense scene can lose small or weak objects in another part of the same video. A large input helps small objects, but it costs the same time on easy and hard frames. The choice therefore moves false positives, missed objects, identity switches, and runtime together.

Existing adaptive methods only partly address this problem. Adaptive inference methods change the detector's input scale or configuration, but they usually need an extra learned model and are designed for detection, not tracking [7, 8]. Adaptive tracking methods change thresholds inside one specific tracker [9, 10]. What is missing is a simple, training-free way to adapt the detector operating point online for MOT, without changing the detector or the tracker.

This paper presents AC-MOT, a training-free control layer that adapts the detector operating point online for aerial MOT. The central idea is to treat the operating point as a control variable of the tracking system rather than as a fixed setting. Every ten frames, AC-MOT reads inexpensive scene cues from the current image and from the boxes the tracker has already reported, estimates how crowded the scene is, and selects one of three operating points. The detector and the tracker are not retrained or modified; only the three values passed to the detector change. What is new is therefore not a detector or a tracker, but the joint, online control of the score threshold, the NMS threshold, and the input resolution for MOT, decided only from information that is available at run time.

The main contributions are:

1. AC-MOT, a training-free and causal control layer that treats the detector operating point as part of the MOT system and adapts it online, with the detector and the tracker unchanged (Sect. 3).
2. An optimization-guided development path from early profiles to the final controller, in which each step is compared with the baseline it was built on and the final thresholds and actions are selected by cross-validation on calibration sequences (Sect. 4).
3. An evaluation on VisDrone2019-MOT with two trackers, ByteTrack and the recent OATrack, using eight MOT metrics and paired bootstrap intervals, together with a transfer to UAVDT without retuning (Sect. 5).
4. A latency measurement showing that the control layer adds only a few milliseconds per frame on a Tesla T4 GPU (Sect. 6).

The rest of the paper is organized as follows. Section 2 describes the datasets and evaluation metrics and reviews related work. Section 3 specifies AC-MOT with all its values, and Section 4 explains how optimization experiments led to this design. The final controller was then frozen; its cue subset, thresholds, and action map were selected on calibration sequences that are separate from the evaluation sequences. Section 5 gives the experimental settings and the results, and Section 6 a discussion. Section 7 concludes the paper.

2 Background and Related Work

This section introduces the datasets and evaluation metrics used in this study, followed by a review of related work on MOT.

2.1 Dataset Description

Two publicly available aerial video datasets, VisDrone2019-MOT [2] and UAVDT [3], are used to develop and evaluate the proposed AC-MOT framework. Both datasets contain videos captured by UAVs, but they differ in their object categories, scene characteristics, and recording conditions. Using these datasets allows us to examine the performance of AC-MOT under different aerial tracking conditions and to study whether the same controller can be applied to a new dataset without changing its settings.

2.1.1 VisDrone2019-MOT

VisDrone2019-MOT is a widely used benchmark for MOT in UAV videos [2]. It contains video sequences recorded by various drone-mounted cameras in 14 cities in China, in urban and rural regions and in both sparse and crowded scenes. The VisDrone benchmark annotates ten object categories, such as pedestrians, cars, buses, and bicycles, with boxes that give the location and identity of each tracked object. Its MOT track uses 96 video clips: 56 for training (24,198 frames), 7 for validation (2,846 frames), 16 for challenge testing (6,322 frames), and 17 for development testing (6,635 frames). Although ten categories are annotated, the official MOT evaluation scores only five of them: pedestrian, car, van, bus, and truck [2].

Tracking objects in VisDrone2019-MOT is challenging for several reasons. First, many objects appear small because the camera is positioned at a considerable distance from the ground. Second, the number of visible objects can change significantly between frames, especially in crowded traffic scenes. Third, UAV movement causes changes in camera position and viewing angle, making it difficult to maintain object identities over time. In addition, changes in lighting, background details, and object occlusion can affect detection quality and tracking performance.

These characteristics make VisDrone2019-MOT suitable for studying the effect of detector settings on MOT. For example, higher input resolution may help detect small objects, while changes in confidence and NMS thresholds can affect the number of detections passed to the tracker. In this study, VisDrone2019-MOT is used to develop the AC-MOT controller, select its parameters, and evaluate its performance with ByteTrack and OATrack. Separate video sequences are used for controller development and final testing. Specifically, eight training clips serve as calibration data for the final controller (Sect. 4.4), and the seven validation clips serve as evaluation data (Sect. 5).

2.1.2 UAVDT

UAVDT is another benchmark designed for object detection and MOT in UAV videos, with a particular focus on vehicles [3]. It consists of 100 video sequences selected from more than 10 hours of video recorded at urban locations such as squares, arterial streets, toll stations, highways, crossings, and T-junctions, at 30 frames per second (FPS) and a resolution of 1080×540 pixels. About 80,000 frames are annotated with 0.84 million boxes of vehicles in three categories: car, truck, and bus. The sequences are recorded under different weather conditions, flying altitudes, and camera viewing angles. These variations produce differences in object size, visibility, background appearance, and the number of vehicles present in each frame. The test set contains 20 sequences for the MOT task [3], and these 20 sequences are used in this study (Sect. 5).

The two datasets serve different purposes in the experimental evaluation. VisDrone2019-MOT is used for controller development and testing, while UAVDT provides an additional evaluation on a different aerial tracking benchmark. This design tests whether the improvements of AC-MOT are limited to the dataset used during development or can also be observed on other aerial videos. Both datasets are evaluated with ByteTrack and OATrack, so the effect of the operating point can also be compared between two tracking algorithms, with the detector and the trackers unchanged.

2.2 MOT Evaluation Metrics

To evaluate the performance of the proposed AC-MOT framework, eight commonly used MOT metrics are considered: Higher Order Tracking Accuracy (HOTA), Multiple Object Tracking Accuracy (MOTA), Identity F1 Score (IDF1), identity switches (IDS), false positives (FP), false negatives (FN), precision, and recall. These metrics measure different aspects of tracking performance, including detection accuracy, object identity consistency, and the ability to track objects across consecutive frames [11, 12]. They are defined below, starting from the errors counted in each frame and ending with the scores that combine them.

Detection errors. The first metrics count the errors made frame by frame. In each frame t, output boxes are matched one to one to ground-truth boxes with an intersection over union (IoU) of at least 0.5. Let GT_t be the number of ground-truth boxes, TP_t the number of matched pairs, FP_t the number of output boxes without a match (false positives), and FN_t the number of ground-truth boxes without a match (false negatives, or missed objects). Over all frames,

$$\mathrm{GT} = \sum_t \mathrm{GT}_t, \qquad \mathrm{TP} = \sum_t \mathrm{TP}_t, \tag{1}$$

$$\mathrm{FP} = \sum_t \mathrm{FP}_t, \qquad \mathrm{FN} = \sum_t \mathrm{FN}_t, \tag{2}$$

so that $\mathrm{TP} = \mathrm{GT} - \mathrm{FN}$. From these counts, precision is the fraction of output boxes that are correct, and recall is the fraction of ground-truth boxes that are found:

$$\mathrm{Precision} = \frac{\mathrm{TP}}{\mathrm{TP} + \mathrm{FP}}, \qquad \mathrm{Recall} = \frac{\mathrm{TP}}{\mathrm{GT}}. \tag{3}$$

Identity switches. The counts above treat each frame separately, so they do not show whether an object keeps the same track over time. Identity switches measure this. Let $\phi_t(i)$ be the output track matched to ground-truth object i in frame t, and $\phi_{\mathrm{prev}}(i)$ the output track to which object i was last matched before t. An identity switch is counted whenever these two tracks differ:

$$\mathrm{IDS} = \sum_t \sum_i \mathbf{1}[\phi_t(i) \neq \phi_{\mathrm{prev}}(i)], \tag{4}$$

where the inner sum runs over the objects that are matched in frame t and were matched before.

MOTA and IDF1. These two scores summarize the errors above in a single number each. MOTA combines the three error types, and IDF1 measures how long each object keeps the correct identity:

$$\mathrm{MOTA} = 1 - \frac{\mathrm{FN} + \mathrm{FP} + \mathrm{IDS}}{\mathrm{GT}}, \tag{5}$$

$$\mathrm{IDF1} = \frac{2\,\mathrm{IDTP}}{2\,\mathrm{IDTP} + \mathrm{IDFP} + \mathrm{IDFN}}. \tag{6}$$

For IDF1, each ground-truth track is first matched to at most one output track over the whole video. IDTP, IDFP, and IDFN are then the true-positive, false-positive, and false-negative boxes under this track-level matching. Because MOTA counts every false positive and every missed object, it reacts strongly to how many boxes the detector passes on. IDF1 depends more on whether each object keeps one identity.

HOTA. MOTA depends mostly on detection errors, and IDF1 mostly on identity errors. HOTA balances detection and association in one score [12]. At a localization threshold α, let TP_α, FN_α, and FP_α be the matched pairs, missed ground-truth boxes, and unmatched output boxes. For a matched pair c, $\mathrm{TPA}(c)$ is the set of matched pairs with the same ground-truth identity and the same output identity as c; $\mathrm{FNA}(c)$ is the set of boxes of the same ground-truth object that are matched to another output identity or not matched; and $\mathrm{FPA}(c)$ is the set of boxes of the same output track that are matched to another object or not matched. Then

$$\mathrm{DetA}_\alpha = \frac{|\mathrm{TP}_\alpha|}{|\mathrm{TP}_\alpha| + |\mathrm{FN}_\alpha| + |\mathrm{FP}_\alpha|}, \tag{7}$$

$$\mathcal{A}(c) = \frac{|\mathrm{TPA}(c)|}{|\mathrm{TPA}(c)| + |\mathrm{FNA}(c)| + |\mathrm{FPA}(c)|}, \tag{8}$$

$$\mathrm{AssA}_\alpha = \frac{1}{|\mathrm{TP}_\alpha|} \sum_{c \in \mathrm{TP}_\alpha} \mathcal{A}(c), \tag{9}$$

$$\mathrm{HOTA} = \frac{1}{19} \sum_\alpha \sqrt{\mathrm{DetA}_\alpha\, \mathrm{AssA}_\alpha}, \tag{10}$$

where α runs over $0.05, 0.10, \ldots, 0.95$.

Statistical comparison. To judge whether the difference between two systems is reliable, paired bootstrap resampling is applied at the sequence level [13]. Resampling whole sequences keeps the dependence within each sequence and gives intervals for system differences. Each resample draws the evaluation sequences with replacement. The same draw is used for both systems, the pooled metrics are recomputed, and their difference is recorded. The 95% interval is the 2.5–97.5 percentile range.

Units and direction. HOTA, MOTA, IDF1, precision, and recall are given in percent; IDS, FP, and FN are counts; speed is given in FPS, and runtime in milliseconds (ms) per frame. Higher values are better for HOTA, MOTA, IDF1, precision, recall, and FPS, and lower values are better for IDS, FP, FN, and runtime.

2.3 MOT Literature Survey

MOT has been widely studied, with research focusing on improving object detection, data association, and tracking accuracy under different operating conditions. Four lines of this work relate directly to AC-MOT. Tracking-by-detection methods provide the detector and tracker that AC-MOT controls. Adaptive threshold methods change settings inside a tracker, and adaptive inference methods change how a detector is running; both are the closest alternatives to AC-MOT. Optimization and evaluation methods are the tools used to develop and test AC-MOT. The following subsections review these four lines in this order.

2.3.1 Tracking-by-Detection Methods in Aerial MOT

Tracking-by-detection is one of the most widely used approaches in MOT. Objects are detected in each frame and then associated across frames to keep their identities. Many methods in this family improve motion prediction or data association for a given detector.

SORT built a compact online pipeline from motion prediction and assignment [5], and StrongSORT adds appearance features to reduce identity fragmentation [14]. ByteTrack first associates high-confidence detections and then uses low-confidence boxes to recover objects that would otherwise be lost [6]. TrackFormer performs detection and association with transformer queries [15]. Standard evaluation follows the MOTChallenge benchmarks [11].

Aerial video adds small targets, changing object counts, camera motion, and clutter [2, 3]. UAVMOT addresses the motion of the UAV camera inside the tracker [16], and LSO-YOLO designs a lightweight real-time detector for small UAV objects [17]. OATrack [18] is a recent UAV small-object tracker published in 2026. It weights association by detection quality and uses a YOLO detection cache. We use OATrack as a second host and keep it unchanged. With the same detector, AC-MOT improves its results in our pipeline: HOTA rises by 1.325, MOTA by 6.318, and IDF1 by 2.258 points, and IDS fall by 169 (Sect. 5). These works improve the tracker or the detector itself. AC-MOT asks a different question: which detector setting should be used for the current scene.

Detector and trackers used in this study. The experiments use the YOLO11m detector [19], a one-stage detector of the Ultralytics YOLO family, in a public version trained on the VisDrone2019-DET dataset [2]. Two of the trackers above serve as hosts. ByteTrack [6] is a widely used tracker whose second association step uses low-score boxes. OATrack [18] is a recent tracker for small UAV objects that weights association by detection quality. Both hosts are used without modification.

2.3.2 Adaptive Threshold Selection in MOT

Several studies have investigated adaptive threshold selection to improve MOT under changing scene conditions. In conventional tracking-by-detection systems, fixed thresholds are commonly used to determine which detections are accepted and how they

are associated with existing tracks. However, the reliability of these thresholds may vary when object density, occlusion, and detection confidence change during a video sequence. Adaptive threshold methods attempt to address this limitation by adjusting selected tracking parameters according to the current conditions.

Adaptive ByteTrack adjusts the confidence threshold used within the ByteTrack [9] algorithm to accommodate variations in detection confidence. This can help the tracker handle objects whose detection scores change because of occlusion, small object size, or changes in image quality. Similarly, AdapTrack [10] adapts the matching thresholds used during data association. By adjusting these thresholds, the tracker can modify its association decisions according to the available detection and tracking information. Although both approaches introduce flexibility into the tracking process, their adaptation mechanisms operate within the tracker and are designed around particular tracking algorithms.

AC-MOT follows a different approach by adapting the detector operating point rather than the internal parameters of the tracker. The detector operating point consists of three parameters: the detection confidence threshold, the NMS IoU threshold, and the input resolution. The confidence threshold decides which low-confidence detections are kept, the NMS threshold controls how overlapping boxes are suppressed, and the input resolution affects both the visibility of small objects and the cost of detection. Changing the three together lets the detector output respond to the scene before the tracking stage.

AC-MOT also does not change the tracking algorithm. It works as an external controller that selects the detector configuration from scene information and previous tracking results, while the tracker keeps its own association and identity management. For this reason the same controller can be used with ByteTrack and with OATrack without modifying or retraining either tracker. AC-MOT thus extends adaptive parameter selection from tracker-specific thresholds to joint control of the detector operating point within the MOT pipeline.

2.3.3 Adaptive Inference for Object Detection

Dynamic neural networks change their structure or parameters for each input [20], and resolution-adaptive networks spend less computation on easy inputs [21]. AdaScale selects the input scale of each video frame with a scale regressor trained on detector features [7]. ApproxDet switches detection configurations at run time with accuracy and latency models trained offline [8]. Chameleon re-profiles the configuration of video analytics pipelines over time [22]. These adaptive inference methods mainly aim to improve detection accuracy, reduce computational cost, or balance the two. To select a configuration, some rely on additional trained models, such as scale predictors or offline accuracy and latency estimators, while others use periodic profiling of the video content. Their adaptation is designed for object detection or video analytics, not for MOT, where a detection error can also break an association or switch an identity.

AC-MOT differs in three ways. It adjusts three detector parameters together, the confidence threshold, the NMS IoU threshold, and the input resolution, with the goal of better tracking rather than better detection. Its controller uses lightweight scene information and previous tracking results, so it needs no additional learned model and no retraining of the detector or the tracker. Finally, it is evaluated with tracking metrics for accuracy, identity preservation, and association, with two different trackers, ByteTrack and OATrack. Table 1 summarizes the main differences between AC-MOT and the closest adaptive methods.

2.3.4 Optimization and Evaluation for MOT

Optimization and performance evaluation play an important role in developing reliable MOT systems. The selection of detector and tracking parameters can affect detection accuracy, object association, identity consistency, and computational efficiency. Since improving one aspect of tracking performance may negatively affect another, systematic optimization methods are needed to explore different parameter configurations and identify suitable trade-offs. In addition, evaluating tracking systems requires metrics that measure both detection and identity preservation, together with statistical methods that assess the reliability of observed performance differences.

Optuna provides define-by-run search with the Tree-structured Parzen Estimator (TPE) sampler [23], which was used throughout the development of AC-MOT. The identity-aware study reports a feasible Pareto front based on the usual notion of non-dominance. The metrics and the paired bootstrap of Sect. 2.2 are used to compare AC-MOT with its baselines.

In summary, existing work adapts either the tracker's own thresholds or the detector's configuration for detection accuracy and cost. A training-free method that adapts the detector operating point online for MOT, with the detector and the tracker left unchanged, is missing. AC-MOT is designed to fill this gap.

Table 1 Adaptive methods closest to AC-MOT (BT: ByteTrack).

Method	Adapted	Where	Task
AdaScale [7]	input scale	detector	video detection
ApproxDet [8]	detection configuration	detector	video detection
Chameleon [22]	pipeline configuration	analytics pipeline	video analytics
Adapt. BT [9]	confidence threshold	inside BT	MOT
AdapTrack [10]	matching thresholds	inside the tracker	MOT
AC-MOT	confidence, NMS, resolution	detector; tracker unchanged	aerial MOT

3 Proposed AC-MOT Framework

AC-MOT is a small, rule-based controller that runs next to the detector. On frame 1 and then on every tenth frame, it does five things in order. It measures a few cheap cues of the current image and of the boxes that the tracker reported for the previous frame (Sect. 3.2). It averages the recent crowd level into a scene complexity index (SCI) (Sect. 3.3). It uses this index and the other cues to choose a target state, LOW, MEDIUM, or HIGH. It then adjusts the target with three rules: a recovery probe for a sudden drop in the object count, and hysteresis and dwell rules that prevent frequent changes (Sect. 3.4). Finally, the resulting state selects one of three fixed detector operating points (Sect. 3.5). Until the next analysis step, the detector and the tracker process the frames with this operating point, exactly as they would with a fixed one. Section 3.6 explains how each value of the controller is chosen, and Table 2 lists the symbols.

3.1 Overview and operating point

Figure 1 shows where AC-MOT sits in the pipeline: the controller chooses the detector settings before the detector runs, and the detector and the tracker then run as usual. The detector settings at frame t are called the operating point

$$\theta_t = (c_t, \eta_t, r_t), \tag{11}$$

which has three parts:

- r_t is the input resolution, the long side of the resized image in pixels. A larger input shows small objects better but takes more time.
- η_t is the NMS IoU threshold. When two boxes overlap with an IoU above η_t, the box with the lower score is removed. A lower η_t removes more overlapping boxes.

Table 2 Symbols computed at run time. Fixed values are listed in Table 4.

Symbol	Meaning
t	frame index
j	analysis step (frames $1, 11, 21, \dots$)
I_t	image of frame t
r_t, η_t, c_t	input resolution, NMS IoU threshold, score threshold used at frame t, Eq. (11)
$\mathcal{B}_{1:t-1}$	boxes reported by the tracker for frames 1 to $t-1$
e_t, β_t, ν_t	edge density, brightness, and sharpness of I_t
N_j	number of tracked boxes in frame $t-1$
a_i	area of tracked box i in pixels
C_j	crowd cue, Eq. (13)
T_j	tiny-object ratio, Eq. (14)
S_j	scene complexity index (SCI), Eq. (15)
H_j	the last seven analysis steps
ℓ_j	scene label, Eq. (16)
g_j	target state, Eqs. (17)–(20)
q_j	controller state: LOW, MEDIUM, or HIGH, Eq. (21)
P_j, d_j	peak object count and drop counter, Eqs. (18)–(19)
t_c	frame of the last state change

- c_t is the score threshold. Boxes with a detector score below c_t are removed before they reach the tracker. A higher c_t passes fewer but more reliable boxes.

The detector weights and the tracker are frozen; AC-MOT changes only θ_t.

The controller uses only information that is available at run time:

$$\theta_t = \pi\left(I_t, \mathcal{B}_{1:t-1}\right), \tag{12}$$

where π is the control rule described in this section, I_t is the image of the current frame, and $\mathcal{B}_{1:t-1}$ are the boxes that the tracker reported for the earlier frames 1 to $t-1$. In words, the decision for frame t uses the current image and the past tracker output. The tracker output of frame t is used only from frame $t+1$ on. No ground truth, no future frame, and no detector score enters the decision.

3.2 Scene cues

The controller needs a cheap description of the scene. Scene analysis therefore does not run on every frame. It runs on frame 1 and then once every 10 frames ($t = 1$ or $t \bmod 10 = 1$, that is, frames 1, 11, 21, ...). Each of these frames is an analysis step j. Between two analysis steps the controller keeps its last decision. The stride of 10 frames is selected by a temporal sweep on validation data that requires at least 25 FPS (Sect. 3.6). Two kinds of cues are computed at each step: image cues, which describe how the current frame looks, and box cues, which describe the objects that the tracker found in the previous frame.

Image cues of the current frame. The frame is reduced to a quarter of its width and height and converted to gray levels, so that the cues are cheap to compute. Three cues are then measured:

- the edge density e_t, the fraction of pixels marked as edges by the Canny detector (lower and upper thresholds 50 and 120); many edges indicate a cluttered scene;
- the brightness β_t, the mean gray level from 0 (black) to 255 (white); a low value indicates a dark or night scene;
- the sharpness ν_t, the variance of the Laplacian of the gray image; a low value indicates a blurred frame.

Box cues of the previous frame. Let N_j be the number of boxes that the tracker reported for frame $t-1$, and let a_i be the area of box i in pixels of the original image. The crowd cue and the tiny-object ratio are

$$C_j = \min\left(\frac{N_j}{30}, 1\right), \tag{13}$$

$$T_j = \frac{1}{N_j}\sum_{i=1}^{N_j} \mathbf{1}\left[a_i < 32^2\right]. \tag{14}$$

C_j is the number of tracked objects divided by 30 and capped at 1, so every frame with 30 or more objects has $C_j = 1$. T_j is the fraction of tracked boxes smaller than 32×32 pixels, which is the size limit of small objects in the COCO benchmark [24]. The indicator $\mathbf{1}[\cdot]$ is 1 when its condition holds and 0 otherwise, and $T_j = 0$ when $N_j = 0$.

3.3 SCI and scene label

The SCI measures how crowded the recent frames are. A single frame is a noisy measurement, because the tracker may miss or add a few objects in any frame, so the SCI averages over time. It is the mean crowd cue of the last seven analysis steps:

$$S_j = \frac{1}{|H_j|}\sum_{k \in H_j} C_k, \tag{15}$$

where H_j holds the steps $j-6, \dots, j$ (fewer at the start of a video) and $|H_j|$ is their number. With a stride of 10 frames, the seven steps cover about the last 60 frames, so a single unusual frame changes S_j only a little. The window of seven steps is selected by the same temporal sweep as the stride (Sect. 3.6). Because $C_j \le 1$, S_j lies between 0 and 1. While fewer than 30 objects are tracked, S_j is simply the recent average number of tracked objects divided by 30.

The SCI uses the crowd cue alone. During development, all 31 combinations of the five cues (crowd, tiny ratio, edges, brightness, and blur) are tested as SCI inputs on the calibration sequences, and the crowd cue alone is selected (Sect. 4.4). The other four cues are still used as checks on the state, mainly through the scene label

$$\ell_j = \begin{cases} \text{night} & \text{if } \beta_t < 80, \\ \text{blur} & \text{else if } \nu_t < 180, \\ \text{tiny} & \text{else if } T_j > 0.50, \\ \text{crowded} & \text{else if } C_j > 0.65 \text{ or } e_t > 0.13, \\ \text{clear} & \text{otherwise.} \end{cases} \tag{16}$$

The conditions are checked from top to bottom, and the first one that holds gives the label. For example, $T_j > 0.50$ means that more than half of the tracked boxes are tiny, and $C_j > 0.65$ means that at least 20 objects are tracked.

Each cue therefore has a specific role. Only the crowd cue enters the SCI, and it also enters the crowded label. The tiny-object ratio T_j is used directly by the state rules of Sect. 3.4 and also gives the tiny label. The edge density e_t is used only through the crowded label. The brightness β_t and the sharpness ν_t are used only through the night and blur labels. These two labels do not lead to MEDIUM or HIGH by themselves. Because they are checked first, their only effect is that a dark or blurred frame cannot receive the crowded or tiny label; the SCI conditions and the tiny-object guard of Eq. (17) still apply to such a frame.

3.4 Three-state controller

The controller is always in one of three states: LOW, MEDIUM, or HIGH. The names describe the scene: LOW for a sparse scene, HIGH for a crowded scene or a scene of mostly tiny objects. They do not rank the input size: in the final action map the HIGH state uses the smallest input (Table 3). The state is updated only at analysis steps, in four steps (Algorithm 1). Step 1 proposes a target state from the cues. Steps 2–4 adjust this target so that the controller reacts to a sudden drop in the object count but does not switch back and forth.

Step 1: target state. The target is the state that the current cues ask for. It is given by the SCI, the tiny-object ratio, and

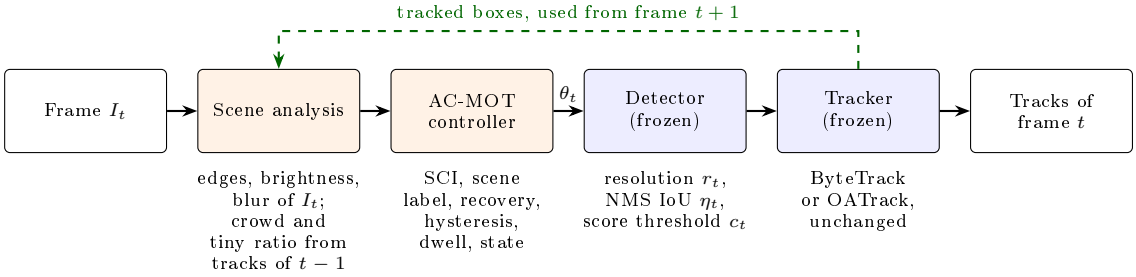


Fig. 1 AC-MOT in a tracking-by-detection pipeline. Scene analysis and the controller choose the operating point $\theta_t = (c_t, \eta_t, r_t)$ before the detector runs. The frozen detector and tracker are not modified. Tracked boxes of frame t feed the scene analysis of later frames (dashed arrow).

the scene label:

$$g_j = \begin{cases} \text{HIGH} & \text{if } S_j > \tau_h \text{ or } T_j > 0.50, \\ \text{MEDIUM} & \text{else if } S_j > \tau_m \text{ or} \\ & \quad \ell_j \in \{\text{crowded}, \text{tiny}\}, \\ \text{LOW} & \text{otherwise,} \end{cases} \tag{17}$$

where $\tau_m = 0.297$ and $\tau_h = 0.511$ are the two SCI thresholds (Table 4). They are selected by the joint search on the calibration sequences (Sect. 3.6). Since S_j is the recent average number of tracked objects divided by 30, the SCI conditions give MEDIUM above about 9 objects ($30\tau_m = 8.9$) and HIGH above about 15 objects ($30\tau_h = 15.3$).

Step 2: recovery probe. The SCI averages seven steps, so it reacts slowly when the tracker suddenly reports far fewer objects than a few steps earlier. The recovery probe responds to such a collapse of the object count. Instead of letting the falling count move the controller toward a lower state, it sets the target to HIGH for a short time. To detect a collapse, it keeps a slowly decaying peak P_j of the object count and a drop counter d_j:

$$d_j = \begin{cases} d_{j-1} + 1 & \text{if } P_{j-1} \geq 5 \text{ and} \\ & \quad N_j < 0.40\, P_{j-1}, \\ 0 & \text{otherwise,} \end{cases} \tag{18}$$

$$P_j = \max\left(N_j, \lfloor 0.8\, P_{j-1} \rfloor\right), \tag{19}$$

with $P_0 = d_0 = 0$. A collapse is detected when at least 5 objects have been seen before and fewer than 40% of them remain. The peak loses 20% at each step, so an old peak is forgotten after a few steps. While $1 \leq d_j \leq 3$, the target g_j is set to HIGH, so the probe lasts at most three analysis steps (30 frames); the dwell rule of Step 4 still applies. The rule and its values come from the original AC-MOT controller and are fixed in all final-stage searches (Sect. 3.6), so the HIGH action used during a probe is selected by the joint search with this rule in place.

Step 3: hysteresis. Without a margin, a scene whose SCI stays close to a threshold would make the controller switch at almost every step. Hysteresis prevents this: a move to a lower state is held while the scene is still close to difficult:

$$g_j \leftarrow \begin{cases} \text{HIGH} & \text{if } q_{j-1} = \text{HIGH and} \\ & \quad (S_j > 0.50 \text{ or } T_j > 0.40), \\ \text{MEDIUM} & \text{if } q_{j-1} = \text{MEDIUM}, \\ & \quad g_j = \text{LOW and } S_j > 0.25, \\ g_j & \text{otherwise.} \end{cases} \tag{20}$$

The hold values lie just below the values that lead into each state ($0.50 < \tau_h$, 0.40 below the tiny guard of 0.50, and $0.25 < \tau_m$). Upward moves are not held.

Step 4: dwell. The dwell rule sets a minimum time between two changes. After a change, the state is kept for at least 30 frames, that is, three analysis steps:

$$q_j = \begin{cases} g_j & \text{if } t - t_c \geq 30, \\ q_{j-1} & \text{otherwise,} \end{cases} \tag{21}$$

Algorithm 1 AC-MOT controller for one video. Steps 1–4 are those of Sect. 3.4. The state is kept between analysis steps, and the boxes stored at frame t are used from frame $t+1$.

Input: frames $I_1, I_2, \ldots$; frozen detector and tracker; constants of Table 4
Output: tracks of every frame

$j \leftarrow 0$; $q_0 \leftarrow$ LOW; $P_0 \leftarrow 0$; $d_0 \leftarrow 0$; $t_c \leftarrow 1$
for each frame $t = 1, 2, \ldots$ **do**
  if $t = 1$ **or** $t \bmod 10 = 1$ **then** ▷ analysis step
    $j \leftarrow j + 1$
    $e_t, \beta_t, \nu_t \leftarrow$ image cues of I_t ▷ Sect. 3.2
    $N_j, C_j, T_j \leftarrow$ box cues of frame $t-1$ ▷ none at $t = 1$
    $S_j \leftarrow$ mean of C_k, $k \in H_j$ ▷ SCI, Eq. (15)
    $\ell_j \leftarrow$ Eq. (16); $g_j \leftarrow$ Eq. (17) ▷ Step 1
    update d_j, P_j, Eqs. (18)–(19)
    if $1 \leq d_j \leq 3$ **then** $g_j \leftarrow$ HIGH ▷ Step 2
    end if
    apply hysteresis to g_j, Eq. (20) ▷ Step 3
    if $t - t_c \geq 30$ **and** $g_j \neq q_{j-1}$ **then** ▷ Step 4
      $q_j \leftarrow g_j$; $t_c \leftarrow t$
    else
      $q_j \leftarrow q_{j-1}$
    end if
  end if
  $(r_t, \eta_t, c_t) \leftarrow$ action of q_j, Table 3
  detect with r_t, η_t; drop boxes with score $< c_t$
  update the tracker; store its boxes
end for

where t_c is the frame of the last state change. The controller starts in LOW with $t_c = 1$, so the first change is possible at frame 31. Whenever $q_j \neq q_{j-1}$, t_c is set to t.

Why changes are kept rare. Each change of state changes the input size and the thresholds, and thus the boxes that reach the tracker. Apart from the recovery probe, the temporal rules let the state follow lasting changes of the scene, not single frames: the seven-step window smooths the SCI over about 60 frames, the holds add a margin below each threshold, and the dwell rule allows at most one change every 30 frames.

Example. Consider a clear, sharp video in which the tracker reports 20 objects of normal size in every frame ($C_j = 0.67$), and only 10 objects from frame 71 on. The controller starts in LOW. The first step sees no earlier boxes ($C_j = 0$), so S_j grows as the window fills: 0.33 at frame 11, 0.44 at frame 21, and 0.50 at frame 31. The target is MEDIUM from frame 11, but the dwell rule keeps LOW until frame 31, where the state becomes MEDIUM. From frame 41, S_j exceeds τ_h and the target is HIGH; the dwell rule delays this change to frame 61. When the scene thins, S_j falls slowly because the window still holds the earlier steps, so the state stays HIGH until frame 101. At frame 111, $S_j = 0.48$ is below both τ_h and the hold value of 0.50, and the state returns to MEDIUM. It then stays in MEDIUM, because 10 tracked objects keep S_j at about 0.33, above τ_m.

The state q_j then selects the operating point from the action map, and the detector uses it until the next analysis step.

Table 3 Action map. State names describe scene difficulty, not a resolution rank. Selected by the joint search on the calibration sequences.

State	Resolution r	NMS IoU η	Score threshold c
LOW	1536	0.70	0.10
MEDIUM	1280	0.45	0.40
HIGH	1088	0.60	0.40

3.5 Action map

Table 3 gives the operating point of each state. The actions are not set by hand: they are selected together with τ_m and τ_h by the joint search on the calibration sequences, whose objective is the change in HOTA, a metric that balances detection and association (Sect. 3.6).

LOW uses the largest input (1536 pixels), loose NMS (0.70), and a low score threshold (0.10), so the detector passes more weak boxes when the scene is sparse. MEDIUM uses 1280 pixels, tight NMS (0.45), and a score threshold of 0.40. HIGH uses 1088 pixels, NMS 0.60, and a score threshold of 0.40. In the two difficult states, the detector therefore passes only boxes with a score of at least 0.40.

The HIGH state, used for crowded scenes and for scenes of mostly tiny objects, thus has the smallest input and a high score threshold. This may look surprising, since a larger input shows small objects better. The search, however, optimizes tracking quality, not the detection of every small object. A score threshold of 0.40 gives the tracker fewer but more reliable boxes; in a separate sweep of fixed score thresholds on the same sequences, at 1088 pixels and NMS 0.45, 0.40 gives the highest pooled HOTA (Sect. 3.6). The smaller input also costs less detector time. Section 5 shows that the main effect of AC-MOT is a more selective detection stream: fewer FP and IDS, with similar or slightly lower recall. This action is the result of the search, not a general rule that crowded scenes need smaller inputs.

The score threshold c_t is applied on the detector side before the tracker. It is separate from any confidence gate inside the tracker, such as the fixed tracker-side gate of OATrack.

3.6 Selection of Parameter Values of the AC-MOT Controller

All values of Tables 3 and 4 are fixed before the final evaluation and are not changed after it. The last column of Table 4 gives the source of each value. There are four sources.

Joint search on the calibration sequences. The SCI thresholds τ_m and τ_h and the action map are selected together by an Optuna TPE search with 60 trials [23]; the search ranges are given in Sect. 4.4. The calibration sequences are eight sequences of the VisDrone2019-MOT training split. They serve as the validation (tuning) data of the final stage and are disjoint from the evaluation sequences. Each trial is scored by four-fold cross-validation, with two sequences held out in each fold, as the mean change in HOTA against the baseline. The candidate values come from existing settings. The input sizes (1088, 1280, and 1536 pixels) and NMS values (0.45, 0.60, and 0.70) are the operating points for which detector outputs are cached; 1536 pixels with NMS 0.70 is the baseline point, and 0.70 is the default NMS value of the Ultralytics detector. The three score thresholds are the low and high thresholds of ByteTrack (0.10 and 0.25) and the confidence gate of OATrack (0.40). In a separate sweep of the score threshold over 0.01, 0.10, 0.25, and 0.40 on the same sequences, at 1088 pixels and NMS 0.45, 0.40 gives the highest pooled HOTA (+0.881 over 0.01) and improves seven of the eight sequences. The frozen policy reaches a mean HOTA gain of 2.447 points over the four folds, with all folds positive (Sect. 4.4).

Cue audit on the calibration sequences. The choice of the crowd cue as the only SCI input comes from testing all 31 non-empty subsets of the five cues with the same cross-validation (Sect. 4.4).

Temporal sweep on the validation split. The analysis stride and the SCI window are selected in the first development stage, with the YOLOv8n pipeline, on the VisDrone2019-MOT validation sequences. The sweep tests 25 combinations: windows of 1, 3, 5, 7, and 9 analysis steps and strides of 1, 5, 10, 15, and 20 frames. Five of the 25 settings meet both constraints of that stage, at least 25 FPS and at most 271 IDS (the IDS of the original controller on the same data). Among them, a window of 7 and a stride of 10 give the highest MOTA, 18.165 against 18.044 for the next setting. Operating-point sweeps on the same data cover input resolutions from 512 to 960 pixels, confidence thresholds from 0.05 to 0.50, and NMS thresholds from 0.30 to 0.80, and define the supported values of the first optimized profiles (Sect. 4).

Fixed design values. The tiny-object area follows the COCO definition of small objects [24]. The remaining values (the crowd normalizer, the Canny thresholds, the label thresholds, the recovery, hold, and dwell values, and the initial state) come from the original AC-MOT controller and are kept unchanged in every search of the final stage. The searched values above are tuned with these values in place, so the selected thresholds and actions are matched to them. For example, the crowd normalizer of 30 only sets the scale of S_j: τ_m and τ_h are searched on this scale and correspond to about 9 and 15 tracked objects.

4 Development of the Final AC-MOT Controller

The controller of Sect. 3 is the result of four development stages, and each stage asked one question. The quality-oriented profile (Sect. 4.1) asked whether a scene index that steers the detector settings can improve tracking over a fixed default operating point. The identity-aware profile (Sect. 4.2) asked what changes when identity stability and speed are explicit objectives. The transfer studies (Sect. 4.3) asked whether these profiles keep their effect on other data and pipelines. The modern stage (Sect. 4.4) asked how the controller should be built for a modern detector with separate calibration data, and produced the frozen controller.

The first three stages are historical. Their controllers differ from the final one: the two profiles used a weighted five-cue index with interpolated confidence and NMS values and three resolution levels, and the SparseTrack study used a single edge-driven NMS rule. They also used other detectors and evaluation protocols. Their numbers are therefore reported in their own tables, each against its own baseline, and are not pooled with the modern results. The end of each stage states what it showed.

4.1 Quality-oriented profile

Baseline. The reference pipeline is the pretrained YOLOv8n detector [25] followed by ByteTrack [6], both at their default settings: confidence threshold 0.25, NMS IoU threshold 0.45, input size 640 pixels, and the default ByteTrack parameters (high threshold 0.25, low threshold 0.10, new-track threshold 0.25, buffer 30 frames, match threshold 0.80). It runs with one fixed operating point for the whole video.

Method. The first optimization-derived profile kept the same detector, used a tuned ByteTrack profile, and searched only on the VisDrone2019-MOT validation split. Five cues were used: crowd count, the fraction of earlier boxes below 32×32 pixels, edge density, low brightness, and low Laplacian variance. Each cue was normalized with validation statistics, and the index was their weighted sum

$$S_j = \sum_{k \in \{c,t,e,n,b\}} w_k \, x_{k,j}, \tag{22}$$

Table 4 Values of the AC-MOT controller and how each value is chosen. Calibration sequences: eight VisDrone2019-MOT training sequences used as tuning data, disjoint from the evaluation sequences. CV: four-fold cross-validation.

Symbol	Meaning	Value	How the value is chosen
τ_m	SCI threshold for MEDIUM, Eq. (17)	0.297	joint TPE search on the calibration sequences, 60 trials, CV
τ_h	SCI threshold for HIGH, Eq. (17)	0.511	same joint search
(r, η, c)	operating point of each state	Table 3	same joint search over $\{1088, 1280, 1536\} \times \{0.45, 0.60, 0.70\} \times \{0.10, 0.25, 0.40\}$
–	SCI input cue	crowd only	cue audit of all 31 cue subsets on the calibration sequences, CV
–	analysis stride	10 frames	temporal sweep of 25 settings on the validation split; highest MOTA with $\geq$25 FPS and $\leq$271 IDS
$\lvert H_j \rvert$	SCI window	7 steps	same temporal sweep
–	tiny-object area	32×32 pixels	COCO small-object limit [24]
–	crowd normalizer, Eq. (13)	30 boxes	original controller; sets the scale on which τ_m, τ_h are searched
–	Canny thresholds (lower, upper)	50, 120	original controller; fixed in all final-stage searches
–	night and blur labels, Eq. (16)	$\beta_t < 80$, $\nu_t < 180$	original controller; fixed in all final-stage searches
–	crowded label, Eq. (16)	$C_j > 0.65$ or $e_t > 0.13$	original controller; fixed in all final-stage searches
–	tiny label and HIGH guard, Eqs. (16), (17)	$T_j > 0.50$	original controller; fixed in all final-stage searches
–	recovery: minimum peak, drop ratio, peak decay, steps	5, 0.40, 0.80, 3	original controller; fixed in all final-stage searches
–	holds in HIGH (S_j, T_j) and MEDIUM (S_j), Eq. (20)	(0.50, 0.40), 0.25	original controller; fixed in all final-stage searches
–	dwell, Eq. (21)	30 frames	original controller; fixed in all final-stage searches
–	initial state	LOW	original controller; fixed in all final-stage searches

where k runs over the five cues (c: crowd, t: tiny ratio, e: edges, n: low brightness, b: blur), $x_{k,j}$ is the normalized value of cue k at analysis step j, and w_k is its weight, with $w_k \geq 0$ and $\sum_k w_k = 1$. The index was averaged over seven analyses taken every ten frames. Confidence and NMS were interpolated linearly between the values at $S = 0$ and $S = 1$, and two sorted thresholds selected one of three resolutions (512, 928, 960 pixels).

An Optuna TPE study [23] jointly searched the five weights, the confidence and NMS end points, and the two thresholds. The resolution levels, the supported confidence values $\{0.25, \ldots, 0.45\}$, the supported NMS values from 0.30 to 0.70, and the temporal settings were fixed beforehand by validation sweeps (Sect. 3.6). The selection rule kept trials with at least 25 FPS and at most 271 IDS (the IDS of the original controller on the same validation data) and then took the highest MOTA, with lower IDS, HOTA, IDF1, and FPS as tie-breaks. The frozen profile (archived as Trial 24) has $w_c = 0.1294928$, $w_t = 0.2217477$, $w_e = 0.4337134$, $w_n = 0.0535577$, $w_b = 0.1614885$, confidence end points $(0.30, 0.40)$, NMS end points $(0.35, 0.35)$, and thresholds $(0.1353494, 0.2872868)$. On validation it reached MOTA 23.038, HOTA 36.110, IDF1 40.758, and IDS 270 at 37.169 FPS.

Comparison. Table 5 compares the profile with the baseline on the historical VisDrone test-dev split, with paired bootstrap intervals (5000 resamples, seed 42). HOTA rises by 5.4051 points, MOTA by 7.2195 points, and IDF1 by 8.8220 points, and throughput rises from 36.528 to 38.985 FPS.

What this stage showed. A scene index that steers the detector settings improved tracking quality over the fixed default point, with HOTA, MOTA, and IDF1 intervals above zero. The IDS interval, $[-114, 219]$, includes zero; the next stage made identity stability an explicit objective. The final controller keeps two parts of this stage: the stride of 10 frames and the window of seven steps from its temporal sweep (Sect. 3.6), and the five kinds of scene cues, which were audited again in the modern stage.

4.2 Identity-aware Pareto profile

Baseline. The baseline is the same YOLOv8n and ByteTrack pipeline at default settings (Sect. 4.1).

Method. Quality is not the only deployment goal; identity stability and compute can move in a different direction from MOTA. The second study kept the same cues, operating levels, temporal settings, and validation data, but changed the question. It maximized MOTA and minimized IDS subject only to FPS $\geq$ 25, without the IDS gate. A seeded TPE sampler ran 49 completed trials. A trial dominated another when it had no lower MOTA and no higher IDS, with at least one strict improvement, and the feasible Pareto front was built from these relations. The balanced candidate maximized an equal-weight score of normalized MOTA and normalized IDS reduction, with HOTA, IDF1, FPS, and trial index as tie-breaks.

Table 5 Quality-oriented profile versus its baseline (YOLOv8n with ByteTrack at default settings) on VisDrone test-dev, historical protocol. Gain: paired bootstrap difference with 95% interval; for IDS it is the reduction.

Metric	Baseline	Quality	Gain [95% CI]
HOTA	28.430	33.835	+5.4051 [4.1273, 6.9022]
MOTA	19.729	26.948	+7.2195 [5.4362, 9.2934]
IDF1	32.724	41.546	+8.8220 [6.9005, 11.0537]
IDS	1235	1184	51 [−114, 219]
FPS	36.528	38.985	–

The selected profile (archived as Trial 22) has weights $w_c = 0.1646453$, $w_t = 0.1746265$, $w_e = 0.5076113$, $w_n = 0.1206956$, $w_b = 0.0324213$, confidence end points $(0.40, 0.40)$, NMS end points $(0.60, 0.35)$, and thresholds $(0.2927136, 0.6661672)$. On validation it reached MOTA 19.330, HOTA 31.651, IDF1 34.226, and IDS 168 at 51.406 FPS.

Comparison. Table 6 compares the profile with the baseline on test-dev. It removes 316 IDS and raises throughput from 36.528 to 46.024 FPS, while HOTA, MOTA, and IDF1 also rise. Against the quality-oriented profile it has 265 fewer IDS $[82, 502]$ and -2.617 HOTA $[-4.004, -1.694]$. The two profiles therefore answer different questions: one favors overall quality and the other favors identity stability and speed.

What this stage showed. The detector operating point controls a trade-off between quality, identity stability, and speed, and the objective of the search decides which side is favored. The next stage tested whether such profiles keep their effect outside the data and pipeline on which they were tuned.

4.3 Transfer and cross-pipeline studies

This stage applied the historical controllers outside their development setting: to a second dataset, and to two other detector–tracker pipelines.

UAVDT. The baseline is again YOLOv8n with ByteTrack at default settings (Sect. 4.1). Both frozen profiles were applied to UAVDT [3] without retuning (Table 7). The quality-oriented

Table 6 Identity-aware profile versus its baseline (YOLOv8n with ByteTrack at default settings) on VisDrone test-dev, historical protocol. Gain: paired bootstrap difference with 95% interval; for IDS it is the reduction.

Metric	Baseline	Identity	Gain [95% CI]
HOTA	28.430	31.218	+2.788 [0.747, 4.660]
MOTA	19.729	23.792	+4.063 [0.952, 6.886]
IDF1	32.724	37.870	+5.146 [2.028, 8.080]
IDS	1235	919	316 [175, 470]
FPS	36.528	46.024	–

Table 7 Historical UAVDT transfer without retuning. Baseline: YOLOv8n with ByteTrack at default settings.

Metric	Baseline	Quality	Identity
HOTA	24.085	28.390	26.930
MOTA	13.841	17.399	16.118
IDF1	27.887	34.453	32.014
IDS	558	321	308
FPS	65.015	58.353	61.462

Table 8 Cross-pipeline study on VisDrone test-dev. Baseline: U2MOT with its YOLOX-X detector at its static setting.

Metric	U2MOT baseline	With controller
MOTA	53.873	53.767
IDF1	69.775	69.849
IDS	1239	1152
FP	41385	40155
FN	63241	64801

Table 9 Cross-pipeline study on MOT17 `val_half`. Baseline: SparseTrack with a fixed NMS IoU threshold of 0.75.

Metric	SparseTrack baseline	With adaptive NMS
MOTA	76.8881	76.9252
IDF1	81.4943	81.5299
IDS	136	123

profile raised HOTA by 4.305 points [2.740, 5.709] and the identity-aware profile by 2.845 points [1.238, 4.348]; their IDS reductions are 237 [104, 377] and 250 [110, 404].

U2MOT on VisDrone. The baseline is the published U2MOT tracker [26] with its released YOLOX-X detector, run at its own static setting. Seven VisDrone validation sequences served for development and 17 test-dev sequences for evaluation. The cue weights and transforms of the quality-oriented profile were kept, the tracker was not modified, and the action boundaries were set to the 33rd and 67th percentiles of the index on the U2MOT validation run, without using ground truth. Table 8 gives the comparison: the controlled pipeline has 87 fewer IDS and 1230 fewer FP, while MOTA is almost unchanged and FN are higher.

SparseTrack on MOT17. The baseline is the published SparseTrack tracker [27] with a fixed NMS IoU threshold of 0.75, on the seven MOT17 `val_half` sequences (2652 frames) [11]. A minimal edge-driven rule switched only the NMS threshold, between 0.70 and 0.80; its threshold came from a leave-one-sequence-out study on the same sequences. Table 9 gives the comparison: the adaptive rule reduces IDS from 136 to 123, with MOTA +0.0371 points [−0.041, +0.182].

What this stage showed. The frozen profiles kept their direction on UAVDT without retuning, and with U2MOT and SparseTrack the control mainly reduced IDS, with small changes in MOTA. Together these studies show that the preferred profile depends on the objective (quality or identity) and on the tracker host. This motivated a modern stage with a stronger detector, explicit calibration data, and two tracker hosts.

4.4 Modern development of the frozen controller

The modern stage started from the scene cues and state logic of the original controller and decided, step by step, which cues enter the SCI, which operating points each state uses, and where the SCI thresholds lie.

Baseline. The modern baseline is the YOLO11m detector [19], in the public VisDrone checkpoint described in Sect. 2.3.1, run at a fixed operating point of 1536 pixels and NMS IoU 0.70 with no extra score threshold. It feeds ByteTrack [6] during development and both ByteTrack and OATrack [18] in the final evaluation. A large fixed input is a common choice for small aerial objects when no adaptation is used.

Data and protocol. Eight sequences of the VisDrone2019-MOT training split (3282 frames) were declared as calibration data. They are disjoint from the seven evaluation sequences. The searches used the same four folds, each holding out two calibration sequences. Detector outputs were cached for every resolution and NMS value; a score threshold applied to the cache was checked to reproduce direct inference exactly. Table 10 summarizes the development steps, which are described below in the order in which they were carried out.

Resolution and NMS maps. Two exhaustive grid searches, archived as Stages 1 and 2, searched the state-to-resolution and state-to-NMS maps. At this point the action of a state contained only the input resolution and the NMS value.

Cue audit. The next search, archived as Stage 3A, asked which cues should form the SCI. It searched all 31 non-empty subsets of the five cues and selected {crowd}, which defines the crowd-selected SCI of Eq. (15). The other cues were kept as guard and auxiliary cues of the state logic (Sect. 3.3).

Score threshold. A separate sweep then tested the score threshold. At 1088 pixels and NMS 0.45, a fixed score threshold of 0.40 raised pooled calibration HOTA by +0.881 over 0.01 and improved seven of the eight sequences. The score threshold was therefore added as the third action dimension.

Final joint search. The final search then selected the thresholds and the three-part actions together. It used 60 TPE trials (seed 43) and searched $\tau_m \in [0.10, 0.50]$, $\tau_h \in [\tau_m + 0.05, \min(\tau_m + 0.40, 0.90)]$, and for each state a resolution in $\{1088, 1280, 1536\}$, an NMS value in $\{0.45, 0.60, 0.70\}$, and a score threshold in $\{0.10, 0.25, 0.40\}$. The objective was the cross-validated (CV) mean change in HOTA against the baseline, with ByteTrack as host. A candidate was eligible only if it really adapted within the video rather than acting as one fixed operating point: it had to realize at least two distinct actions, each on at least 10% of calibration frames, and switch within sequences. The frozen policy is the eligible candidate whose three states use three different actions that together vary all three parts of the operating point (Table 3). On calibration data it used LOW, MEDIUM, and HIGH on 7.6%, 10.1%, and 82.3% of frames, with 0.607 state changes per 100 frames on average.

Comparison. Table 11 compares the frozen policy with the baseline on each calibration fold. All four folds are positive, with a CV mean of +2.447 HOTA. After these steps the thresholds, cue subset, and action map were frozen. Compared with the historical profiles, the final controller is simpler: one crowd index instead of a weighted five-cue index, and three fixed actions instead of interpolated confidence and NMS values. The final comparison on the evaluation sequences is given in Sect. 5.

Table 10 Main modern development steps on the eight calibration sequences (ByteTrack host). The score-threshold gain is pooled HOTA; the joint-search result is the mean over four folds.

Step	Search	Result
Cue subset	31 subsets	{crowd}
Score threshold	4 values	0.40; +0.881 HOTA
Joint search	60 TPE trials	CV mean +2.447

Table 11 Frozen policy versus the modern baseline (YOLO11m at 1536 pixels and NMS 0.70, ByteTrack) on the four calibration folds: change in HOTA.

	Fold 1	Fold 2	Fold 3	Fold 4	Mean
ΔHOTA	+0.592	+4.164	+2.029	+3.004	+2.447

5 Results

The experiments ask one question: with the same detector and the same tracker, does replacing the fixed operating point by the frozen AC-MOT controller improve tracking? The VisDrone evaluation answers this on the dataset used for development, and the UAVDT transfer answers it on a second dataset without any retuning.

All experiments use the YOLO11m detector of Sect. 2.3.1. It runs in half precision, and detections of the classes pedestrian, car, van, truck, and bus are passed on. ByteTrack uses the Ultralytics implementation with its default parameters: high threshold 0.25, low threshold 0.10, new-track threshold 0.25, buffer 30 frames, and match threshold 0.80. OATrack is a re-implementation of the published method [18] in its main configuration, with its published tracker-side confidence gate of 0.40. This gate belongs to the tracker and is never changed by AC-MOT. For each host, two systems are compared. The baseline runs the detector at the fixed operating point of 1536 pixels and NMS IoU 0.70, with a minimal score threshold of 0.01. This is the largest input of the operating-point grid, and 0.70 is the default NMS value of the Ultralytics detector. AC-MOT runs the frozen controller of Sect. 3 on the same detector. The two systems differ only in the detector operating point. Uncertainty is estimated with the paired bootstrap of Sect. 2.2, with 5000 resamples (seed 42). Latency is measured on one Tesla T4 GPU over the first 200 frames of sequence `uav0000086_00000_v`, excluding five warm-up frames. For every frame, the time spent in the controller (image statistics, scene analysis, and state update) is recorded separately from the detector and tracker time.

5.1 Frozen VisDrone evaluation

The VisDrone evaluation uses seven sequences of the VisDrone2019-MOT validation split. They contain 71,830 ground-truth boxes. The cue subset, thresholds, and action map of the frozen controller were selected on the separate calibration sequences only (Sect. 4.4). Results are scored with a Python port of the VisDrone2019-MOT Task 4b evaluation. Ignored regions are removed, the five classes above are evaluated separately, CLEAR-MOT and identity measures use IoU 0.5, and counts are summed over classes and sequences. HOTA is added with the same class-aware scheme using TrackEval. The bootstrap draws seven sequences with replacement.

Table 12 lists the aggregate results on the seven VisDrone sequences, and Fig. 2 shows HOTA, MOTA, and IDF1.

ByteTrack host. AC-MOT changes HOTA from 41.586 to 44.523, MOTA from 9.876 to 27.871, and IDF1 from 48.569 to 53.929. IDS fall from 1341 to 1016 and FP from 39274 to 24892, while FN rise from 24121 to 25902. Precision rises from 54.849 to 64.852 and recall falls from 66.419 to 63.940. The detector output becomes more selective: clutter and identity-confusing boxes are removed at a small cost in recall. The very low baseline MOTA shows how many FP the fixed operating point passes to this tracker. Because MOTA counts every FP, the removal of more than a third of them is the main source of the MOTA gain.

OATrack host. AC-MOT changes HOTA from 46.770 to 48.095, MOTA from 28.165 to 34.483, and IDF1 from 57.107 to 59.364. IDS fall from 773 to 604, FP from 25394 to 21400, and FN from 25432 to 25057. Precision rises from 64.628 to 68.609 and recall from 64.594 to 65.116. OATrack starts from a stronger baseline, and its gains are smaller, but every one of these metrics moves in the direction of improvement.

Paired bootstrap. Table 13 gives the paired differences (AC-MOT minus baseline) and their 95% intervals. With ByteTrack, the intervals of HOTA, MOTA, IDF1, precision, IDS, and FP lie entirely on the side of improvement, and FN and recall move in the opposite direction. With OATrack, HOTA, MOTA, IDF1, and precision rise and IDS and FP fall, all with intervals on

Table 12 Frozen VisDrone evaluation on seven VisDrone2019-MOT sequences (71,830 ground-truth boxes). Baseline: fixed operating point (1536, 0.70).

	ByteTrack		OATrack	
Metric	Baseline	AC-MOT	Baseline	AC-MOT
HOTA	41.586	44.523	46.770	48.095
MOTA	9.876	27.871	28.165	34.483
IDF1	48.569	53.929	57.107	59.364
IDS	1341	1016	773	604
FP	39274	24892	25394	21400
FN	24121	25902	25432	25057
Precision	54.849	64.852	64.628	68.609
Recall	66.419	63.940	64.594	65.116

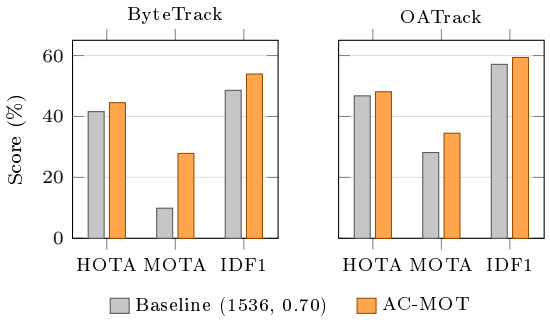


Fig. 2 HOTA, MOTA, and IDF1 on the seven VisDrone sequences for both tracker hosts (values in Table 12).

Table 13 Paired sequence-level bootstrap on VisDrone: AC-MOT minus baseline, 5000 resamples, seed 42. HOTA, MOTA, IDF1, precision, and recall in points; IDS, FP, and FN in counts.

Host	Metric	Difference	95% interval
ByteTrack	HOTA	+2.937	[+2.356, +3.375]
	MOTA	+17.995	[+13.541, +23.282]
	IDF1	+5.360	[+4.490, +6.178]
	IDS	−325	[−498, −164]
	FP	−14382	[−19176, −9620]
	FN	+1781	[+288, +3594.075]
	Precision	+10.003	[+8.712, +11.895]
	Recall	−2.479	[−4.507, −0.469]
OATrack	HOTA	+1.325	[+0.200, +2.264]
	MOTA	+6.318	[+4.741, +7.879]
	IDF1	+2.258	[+0.548, +3.474]
	IDS	−169	[−292, −42]
	FP	−3994	[−6190, −2494.900]
	FN	−375	[−1462.575, +670]
	Precision	+3.981	[+2.957, +5.511]
	Recall	+0.522	[−0.869, +2.111]

Table 14 Frozen UAVDT transfer without retuning (20 sequences, 16,592 frames, one vehicle class). Baseline: fixed operating point (1536, 0.70).

	ByteTrack		OATrack	
Metric	Baseline	AC-MOT	Baseline	AC-MOT
HOTA	45.923	47.004	47.728	47.640
MOTA	−1.573	16.028	19.607	22.873
IDF1	58.400	61.767	62.101	62.931
IDS	601	486	517	486
FP	279616	212077	197937	183669
FN	66050	73702	75612	78774
Precision	49.571	55.751	57.270	58.800
Recall	80.625	78.381	77.820	76.893

Table 15 Paired sequence-level bootstrap on UAVDT: AC-MOT minus baseline, 5000 resamples, seed 42, 20 sequences. MOTA and IDF1 in points; IDS, FP, and FN in counts.

Host	Metric	Difference	95% interval
ByteTrack	MOTA	+17.601	[+11.134, +26.767]
	IDF1	+3.367	[+1.676, +5.013]
	IDS	−115	[−211.025, −26.975]
	FP	−67539	[−104215.350, −37352.950]
	FN	+7652	[+1542.925, +18359.400]
OATrack	MOTA	+3.267	[+0.607, +5.881]
	IDF1	+0.831	[+0.125, +1.271]
	IDS	−31	[−101, +39]
	FP	−14268	[−33958.075, −2188.950]
	FN	+3162	[−211.100, +8959.050]

one side of zero. Because whole sequences are resampled, these intervals reflect the variation between videos, not only between frames.

Controller behaviour. The controller uses all three states with both hosts. With ByteTrack, LOW, MEDIUM, and HIGH cover 7.4%, 30.1%, and 62.5% of the frames; with OATrack they cover 7.4%, 33.3%, and 59.3%. For most of the video, the detector therefore runs with the HIGH action, the smallest input and a score threshold of 0.40. The two hosts diverge through their different tracked boxes. State changes are rare, between 0.10 and 0.54 per 100 frames depending on the sequence, so the detector input stays stable over long stretches of video.

5.2 Frozen UAVDT transfer

The UAVDT transfer tests whether the frozen controller still helps on a dataset with other scenes, object types, and recording conditions, when none of its values is changed. It uses 20 test sequences with 16,592 frames, scored with one vehicle class. The frozen controller, thresholds, and action map are applied without any change. Detector outputs for UAVDT were produced at the three frozen operating points, giving 49,776 detector forward passes. UAVDT is a single frozen run per host. The paired bootstrap draws 20 sequences with replacement from these runs. It is computed from the stored per-sequence counts of the two systems and therefore covers the count-based metrics MOTA, IDF1, IDS, FP, and FN.

Table 14 and Fig. 3 report the transfer to UAVDT without retuning. With ByteTrack, HOTA changes from 45.923 to 47.004 (+1.081), MOTA from −1.573 to 16.028 (+17.601), and IDF1 from 58.400 to 61.767 (+3.367). IDS fall by 115 and FP by 67539, while FN rise by 7652. With OATrack, MOTA changes from 19.607 to 22.873 (+3.267), IDF1 from 62.101 to 62.931 (+0.831), IDS fall by 31, and FP fall by 14268, while HOTA is almost unchanged (47.728 and 47.640). With both hosts the transfer gives fewer FP and IDS and higher precision, with slightly lower recall, the same pattern as with ByteTrack on VisDrone. The controller therefore changes the detector output in the same way on a dataset that was not used to build it.

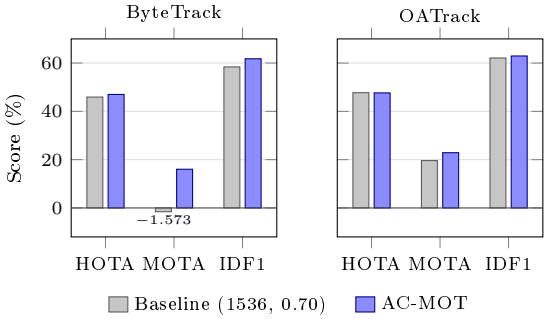


Fig. 3 HOTA, MOTA, and IDF1 of the frozen UAVDT transfer for both tracker hosts (values in Table 14). The ByteTrack baseline MOTA is negative (−1.573); the solid line marks zero.

Table 15 gives the paired bootstrap differences on UAVDT. With ByteTrack, the intervals of MOTA, IDF1, IDS, and FP lie entirely on the side of improvement, and FN moves in the opposite direction. With OATrack, MOTA and IDF1 rise and FP fall, with intervals on one side of zero, while the intervals of IDS and FN include zero.

6 Discussion

The operating point is part of the MOT system. The same frozen detector and the same trackers give very different MOT results at different operating points. Moving away from the fixed 1536/0.70 point raises MOTA by 17.995 points with ByteTrack and by 6.318 points with OATrack on VisDrone. The detector operating point is therefore a first-order variable of aerial MOT and deserves the same attention as the association method.

A more selective detection stream. The main effect of AC-MOT is a more selective detection stream. FP and IDS drop sharply, precision rises, and FN rise a little with ByteTrack. MOTA reacts most strongly because it counts FP directly; HOTA and IDF1 rise by smaller amounts. The same pattern appears on UAVDT, where FP fall by 67539 with ByteTrack and by 14268 with OATrack.

Tracker dependence. ByteTrack gains more than OATrack. ByteTrack starts from a weaker baseline and uses low-score boxes in its second association step, so a likely reason is that removing clutter helps it directly. OATrack already weights detections by quality inside its association, and it gains mainly in MOTA, IDF1, IDS, and FP. Results are therefore reported per host.

Development path. The historical profiles showed that the preferred operating point depends on the goal: quality or identity stability and speed. The transfer studies showed that the effect also depends on the tracker host. The modern stage turned these observations into a finite, readable controller with one crowd index, a few guard cues, three states, and three actions. Its cue subset, thresholds, and actions were selected on calibration sequences, and its results are reported per host.

Deployment. AC-MOT needs no training and no access to detector or tracker internals. It changes three arguments of the detector call. Its analysis runs on a quarter-scale image every ten frames and uses boxes that the tracker already produced. On a Tesla T4 the controller takes 4.26 ms per frame with ByteTrack and 4.20 ms with OATrack, which is small next to detector inference. The control layer therefore adds very little latency and is suitable for real-time use. The same interface can host other action maps, for example maps chosen for a latency budget, without changes to the detector or the tracker.

7 Conclusion

This paper presented AC-MOT, a training-free method that adjusts the detector operating point online to improve MOT in UAV videos. Instead of using fixed detector settings, AC-MOT

changes the confidence threshold, the NMS IoU threshold, and the input resolution as the scene changes. It uses only the current frame and previous tracking results, and it does not change or retrain the detector or the tracker. The SCI, which is based on object density, together with a few other scene cues and a three-state controller with recovery, hysteresis, and dwell rules, lets the settings follow the scene without frequent changes.

The controller was developed through optimization experiments, and its final values were selected by cross-validation on separate calibration sequences and then kept fixed.

On seven VisDrone2019-MOT sequences, AC-MOT improved HOTA by 2.937 points with ByteTrack and 1.325 points with OATrack, and MOTA by 17.995 and 6.318 points, respectively; paired bootstrap analysis gave confidence intervals for these differences. On UAVDT, the same controller improved MOTA by 17.601 points with ByteTrack and 3.267 points with OATrack without retuning.

Overall, the results show that the detector operating point should be treated as part of the tracking system rather than as a fixed setting. Future work will test the controller with more detectors, trackers, and aerial video datasets.

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